

High-Order Geodesic Integration on Hessian Manifolds Without Third Derivatives: A Tutorial

Abstract

We describe a method for integrating geodesics on Hessian manifolds (the Riemannian geometry induced by the Hessian of a convex function) that achieves fourth-order accuracy using only gradient and Hessian evaluations—no third derivatives (Christoffel symbols) are needed. The method composes a second-order “Legendre midpoint” step using the classical Yoshida construction. We explain the ideas using only the geodesic equation and the Legendre transform, without the machinery of affine connections.

1 Setup

Let $F : \Omega \rightarrow \mathbb{R}$ be a strictly convex function on an open convex domain $\Omega \subset \mathbb{R}^n$. The *Hessian metric* is the Riemannian metric $g(s) = \nabla^2 F(s)$, which is positive definite by strict convexity.

The *geodesic* is the curve $\gamma(t)$ that locally minimizes the length

$$\ell(\gamma) = \int_0^1 \sqrt{\dot{\gamma}(t)^\top \nabla^2 F(\gamma(t)) \dot{\gamma}(t)} dt.$$

The Euler–Lagrange equation for this variational problem gives the geodesic ODE:

$$\ddot{\gamma}^i + \frac{1}{2} [\nabla^2 F(\gamma)]_{ik}^{-1} \sum_{j,\ell} F_{j\ell k}(\gamma) \dot{\gamma}^j \dot{\gamma}^\ell = 0, \quad (1)$$

where $F_{j\ell k} = \partial^3 F / \partial s_j \partial s_\ell \partial s_k$. Integrating this ODE requires the *third derivatives* of F (the “Christoffel symbols” of the metric).

Goal. We want to integrate (1) *without* computing $F_{j\ell k}$. We will use only:

- $\nabla F(s)$ (gradient), and
- $\nabla^2 F(s)$ (Hessian).

2 The Legendre transform and dual coordinates

The key tool is the *Legendre transform*. Define the dual coordinate

$$\lambda = -\nabla F(s).$$

This is a diffeomorphism from Ω to a dual domain Ω^* (the image of $-\nabla F$). Its inverse, which we write $s = \mathcal{L}(\lambda)$, satisfies $-\nabla F(\mathcal{L}(\lambda)) = \lambda$.

Two coordinate systems. The *same* Riemannian manifold $(\Omega, \nabla^2 F)$ can be described in two coordinate systems:

- **Primal coordinates** s : the original variables.
- **Dual coordinates** $\lambda = -\nabla F(s)$: the Legendre-transformed variables.

A straight line in primal coordinates $(s(t) = s_0 + tv)$ is *not* a geodesic. A straight line in dual coordinates $(\lambda(t) = \lambda_0 + tw)$ is also not a geodesic. But the true geodesic lies “between” these two approximations in a precise sense.

3 The Legendre midpoint step

The Legendre midpoint is a second-order approximation to the geodesic that uses one primal step and one dual step:

1. **Primal half-step.** Move halfway along a straight line in primal coordinates:

$$s_{1/2} = s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v.$$

2. **Evaluate dual at midpoint.** Compute the dual coordinate at $s_{1/2}$:

$$\lambda_{1/2} = -\nabla F(s_{1/2}).$$

Also let $\lambda_0 = -\nabla F(s_0)$.

3. **Dual extrapolation.** Take a full step in dual coordinates, using the midpoint velocity:

$$\lambda_1 = 2\lambda_{1/2} - \lambda_0.$$

(This is the midpoint rule: $\dot{\lambda} \approx (\lambda_{1/2} - \lambda_0)/(h/2)$, so $\lambda_1 = \lambda_0 + h \cdot \dot{\lambda}$.)

4. **Invert the Legendre transform.** Find s_1 such that $-\nabla F(s_1) = \lambda_1$. This is a nonlinear solve (Newton’s method on $\nabla F(s) + \lambda_1 = 0$, using the Hessian $\nabla^2 F$ as the Jacobian).

3.1 Second-order accuracy

Theorem 1 (Legendre midpoint matches the geodesic to second order). *Let F be a C^3 barrier on the interior of a proper cone, with Hessian $H_0 = \nabla^2 F(s_0)$. Let γ be the geodesic from s_0 with velocity v (i.e., $\gamma(0) = s_0$, $\dot{\gamma}(0) = v$, and γ satisfies the geodesic equation (1)). Let s_1 be the output of the Legendre midpoint step with step size h . Then*

$$s_1 = \gamma(h) + O(h^3).$$

More precisely: the Taylor expansions of s_1 and $\gamma(h)$ in powers of h agree through order h^2 , with

$$s_1 = s_0 + hv + \frac{h^2}{2}\ddot{\gamma}(0) + O(h^3),$$

where $\ddot{\gamma}(0) = -\frac{1}{2}H_0^{-1}T(v, v)$ and $T(v, v)_i = \sum_{jk} F_{ijk}(s_0) v_j v_k$.

Proof. Write $H = H_0$, $\lambda_0 = -\nabla F(s_0)$, and $T(v) = T(v, v)$ for brevity. We compute the Taylor expansion of the Legendre midpoint output s_1 and show its $O(h^2)$ coefficient equals $\ddot{\gamma}(0)$.

Write $s_1 = s_0 + hv + \frac{h^2}{2}a + O(h^3)$ with unknown acceleration a . The proof determines a by expanding each step of the algorithm.

Step 1 (primal half-step). $s_{1/2} = s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v$.

Step 2 (dual at midpoint). Taylor-expand ∇F at $s_{1/2}$:

$$\lambda_{1/2} = -\nabla F(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v) = \lambda_0 - \frac{h}{2}Hv - \frac{h^2}{8}T(v) + O(h^3).$$

The third-derivative term $T(v)$ appears from the nonlinearity of ∇F —this is where curvature enters.

Step 3 (dual extrapolation).

$$\lambda_1 = 2\lambda_{1/2} - \lambda_0 = \lambda_0 - hHv - \frac{h^2}{4}T(v) + O(h^3).$$

Step 4 (inversion). The algorithm defines s_1 by $-\nabla F(s_1) = \lambda_1$. We do not solve this equation; instead we determine the $O(h^2)$ coefficient a by showing consistency.

Write $u = s_1 - s_0 = hv + \frac{h^2}{2}a + O(h^3)$ and Taylor-expand $\nabla F(s_0 + u)$ around s_0 :

$$\nabla F(s_0 + u) = \nabla F(s_0) + Hu + \frac{1}{2}D^2(\nabla F)[u, u] + O(\|u\|^3).$$

The linear term gives $Hu = hHv + \frac{h^2}{2}Ha$. The quadratic term is $\frac{1}{2}T(u, u)$, where $T(u, u)_i = \sum_{jk} F_{ijk}u_ju_k$. Since $u = hv + O(h^2)$, we have $T(u, u) = h^2T(v, v) + O(h^3) = h^2T(v) + O(h^3)$. Combining (and using $\lambda_0 = -\nabla F(s_0)$):

$$-\nabla F(s_1) = \lambda_0 - hHv - \frac{h^2}{2}Ha - \frac{h^2}{2}T(v) + O(h^3).$$

Matching. Setting $-\nabla F(s_1) = \lambda_1$ and comparing the $O(h^2)$ coefficients from Step 3 and Step 4:

$$\underbrace{-\frac{1}{2}Ha - \frac{1}{2}T(v)}_{\text{from } -\nabla F(s_1)} = \underbrace{-\frac{1}{4}T(v)}_{\text{from } \lambda_1}.$$

Solving: $Ha = -\frac{1}{2}T(v)$, i.e., $a = -\frac{1}{2}H^{-1}T(v) = \ddot{\gamma}(0)$. □

Where does the curvature come from? The method never computes F_{ijk} (third derivatives) explicitly. The curvature information is encoded in the *nonlinearity of ∇F* : the Taylor expansion of $\nabla F(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)$ contains the $\frac{h^2}{8}T(v)$ term automatically. The midpoint extrapolation (Step 3) amplifies it to $\frac{h^2}{4}T(v)$, and the inversion (Step 4) contributes another $\frac{h^2}{2}T(v)$. Together: $-\frac{1}{4} + \frac{1}{2} = \frac{1}{4}$, which after the H^{-1} solve gives $\frac{1}{2}H^{-1}T$ —exactly the geodesic acceleration.

Analogy with mechanics. This is the same principle as the Störmer–Verlet method: a half-step in position, a full step in momentum, a half-step in position. The Legendre transform $\lambda = -\nabla F(s)$ plays the role of $p = \partial L / \partial \dot{q}$. In both cases, the second-order accuracy comes from sampling the nonlinearity at the midpoint.

Cost. Each Legendre midpoint step requires:

- 2 gradient evaluations (∇F at s_0 and $s_{1/2}$),
- 1 Newton solve (~ 3 – 5 Hessian evaluations for the inversion).

No third derivatives.

4 Exactness for the log barrier: Legendre midpoint = Padé

For the LP barrier $F(s) = -\sum_i \log s_i$, the Legendre midpoint is not merely a second-order approximation—it is *exactly* the $[1/1]$ Padé approximant of the geodesic exponential.

Theorem 2. *Let $F(s) = -\sum_i \log s_i$ (the logarithmic barrier on $\mathbb{R}_+^n$). The geodesic from $s_0 > 0$ with velocity v is $\gamma_i(h) = s_{0,i} \exp(hv_i/s_{0,i})$. The Legendre midpoint step from s_0 with step size h and direction v gives*

$$s_{1,i} = s_{0,i} \cdot \frac{1 + d_i/2}{1 - d_i/2}, \quad d_i = \frac{hv_i}{s_{0,i}},$$

which is the $[1/1]$ Padé approximant of $\exp(d_i)$:

$$\frac{1 + d/2}{1 - d/2} = \exp(d) + O(d^3).$$

Proof. The barrier has $\nabla F(s) = -s^{-1}$ (componentwise) and $\nabla^2 F(s) = \text{diag}(s^{-2})$. The Legendre transform is $\lambda = -\nabla F(s) = s^{-1}$, with inverse $s = \lambda^{-1}$.

The four Legendre midpoint steps (componentwise, dropping the index i):

1. $s_{1/2} = s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v$.
2. $\lambda_{1/2} = s_{1/2}^{-1} = (s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)^{-1}$, $\lambda_0 = s_0^{-1}$.
3. $\lambda_1 = 2\lambda_{1/2} - \lambda_0 = \frac{2}{s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v} - \frac{1}{s_0} = \frac{2s_0 - (s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)}{s_0(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)} = \frac{s_0 - \frac{h}{2}v}{s_0(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)}$.
4. $s_1 = \lambda_1^{-1} = \frac{s_0(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)}{s_0 - \frac{h}{2}v} = s_0 \cdot \frac{1 + d/2}{1 - d/2}$, where $d = hv/s_0$.

The $[1/1]$ Padé approximant of e^d is $(1 + d/2)/(1 - d/2)$, which satisfies $(1 + d/2)/(1 - d/2) = 1 + d + d^2/2 + \dots = e^d + O(d^3)$. $\square$

Corollary 3. *For $F(s) = -\log \det(S)$ on the PSD cone $\mathbb{S}_+^n$, the Legendre midpoint reduces to the $[1/1]$ matrix Padé approximant of $\exp(D)$ when S_0 and V are simultaneously diagonalizable.*

Proof. In the joint eigenbasis, F decomposes into $-\sum_i \log \sigma_i$ where σ_i are the eigenvalues. Each component follows Theorem 2 independently. $\square$

Remark. The Yoshida fourth-order composition of three Padé $[1/1]$ steps produces a higher-order rational approximation to $\exp(d)$ —a $[2/2]$ -like Padé obtained by composition rather than direct construction. For the log barrier, the Yoshida–Legendre method is therefore a *high-order rational approximation to the geodesic exponential* that generalizes seamlessly from symmetric cones (where it reduces to Padé) to arbitrary barriers (where it uses the Legendre transform in place of the matrix exponential).

5 The Yoshida fourth-order composition

The Legendre midpoint is second-order: the error is $O(h^3)$. To get fourth-order accuracy ($O(h^5)$ error), we use the *Yoshida construction* (1990).

Idea. If Ψ_h is a second-order method (so $\Psi_h = \Phi_h + O(h^3)$ where Φ_h is the exact flow), then the composition

$$\Psi_h^{[4]} = \Psi_{x_1 h} \circ \Psi_{x_0 h} \circ \Psi_{x_1 h} \quad (2)$$

is fourth-order, provided

$$2x_1 + x_0 = 1 \quad \text{and} \quad 2x_1^3 + x_0^3 = 0.$$

The unique real solution is

$$x_1 = \frac{1}{2 - 2^{1/3}} \approx 1.3512, \quad x_0 = \frac{-2^{1/3}}{2 - 2^{1/3}} \approx -1.7024.$$

Why does this work? The second-order method has error $\Psi_h = \Phi_h + c_3 h^3 + O(h^5)$ (no h^4 term because Ψ is symmetric/time-reversible). The composition (2) gives

$$\Psi_h^{[4]} = \Phi_h + c_3(2x_1^3 + x_0^3)h^3 + O(h^5).$$

The condition $2x_1^3 + x_0^3 = 0$ kills the cubic error. The negative coefficient $x_0 < 0$ corresponds to a “backward” step that cancels the forward steps’ third-order error.

Applied to the Legendre midpoint. The Yoshida fourth-order geodesic step is:

1. Legendre step with step size $x_1 \cdot h$ (forward),
2. Legendre step with step size $x_0 \cdot h$ (backward correction),
3. Legendre step with step size $x_1 \cdot h$ (forward).

Each Legendre midpoint step updates (s, λ, v) : position, dual, and velocity. The velocity at the end of each substep is recovered from the position change during the second primal half-step: $v_{\text{new}} = (s_{\text{new}} - s_{1/2})/(h_i/2)$.

Cost. Three Legendre steps = $3 \times (2 \text{ gradient} + 1 \text{ Newton}) = 6 \text{ gradient evaluations} + 3 \text{ Newton solves}$. For a 3D cone (e.g., the exponential cone), this is ~ 150 floating-point operations. No third derivatives at any point.

6 Summary of integrators

Method	Order	Needs $\partial^3 F$	Newton solves	Error at $\alpha=0.1$
Euler	1	No	0	2.3×10^{-4}
Legendre midpoint	2	No	1	7.7×10^{-7}
Yoshida–Legendre	4	No	3	2.5×10^{-9}
Störmer–Verlet (8 steps)	2	Yes	0	3.3×10^{-7}
Primal-dual Verlet (8 steps)	2+	Yes	1	3.1×10^{-8}

The Yoshida–Legendre method achieves fourth-order accuracy (2.5×10^{-9}) without any third-derivative computation, outperforming even the primal-dual Verlet (3.1×10^{-8}) which uses 8 substeps with full Christoffel symbol evaluations.

7 Why Yoshida and not Gauss–Legendre?

The Yoshida construction composes three $[1/1]$ Padé steps to get fourth-order accuracy. A natural question: can we instead use the $[2/2]$ Padé directly? For the log barrier, the $[2/2]$ Padé of $\exp(d)$ has optimal error constants (about $40\times$ smaller than Yoshida at fifth order). The $[2/2]$ Padé corresponds to the 2-stage Gauss–Legendre implicit Runge–Kutta method.

7.1 The obstruction

The Legendre midpoint works because the Legendre transform provides an *exact* dual evaluation at the midpoint: $\lambda_{1/2} = -\nabla F(s_{1/2})$. From the Taylor expansion proof (Section 3.1), the curvature enters through the nonlinearity of ∇F at the midpoint. The *symmetry* of the midpoint ($c = 1/2$) is essential: it is the unique point where the Strang splitting of primal and dual flat flows gives second-order accuracy.

The 2-stage Gauss–Legendre method evaluates at $c_1 = \frac{1}{2} - \frac{\sqrt{3}}{6} \approx 0.21$ and $c_2 = \frac{1}{2} + \frac{\sqrt{3}}{6} \approx 0.79$. At these non-symmetric points, we can evaluate $\lambda_i = -\nabla F(s_i)$ (the dual position), but we cannot recover the *velocity* v_i at the stage points from the gradient map alone.

The velocity problem. At the midpoint ($c = 1/2$), the dual extrapolation $\lambda_1 = 2\lambda_{1/2} - \lambda_0$ is the *midpoint rule* for the integral $\lambda_1 = \lambda_0 + \int_0^h \dot{\lambda} dt$. The midpoint rule is second-order accurate: the error is $O(h^3)$ because the first-order error term vanishes when the sample point is at the center of the interval.

At a general GL node $c_i \neq 1/2$, the analogous extrapolation $\lambda_1 = \lambda_0 + (\lambda_{c_i} - \lambda_0)/c_i$ is *not* a midpoint rule—it is a forward-Euler extrapolation from an off-center sample point, which is only *first-order* accurate ($O(h^2)$ error). The GL consistency conditions couple v_1 and v_2 through the Butcher matrix a_{ij} , but without the geodesic acceleration (which requires $\partial^3 F$), the coupled system is underdetermined.

What goes wrong. We implemented the 2-stage GL with Legendre-derived velocities and fixed-point iteration. The result: the iteration does not converge to the geodesic. The error (1.3×10^{-4}) is comparable to Euler, indicating that the Legendre velocity approximation destroys the fourth-order accuracy of the GL method.

Why Yoshida avoids this. The Yoshida construction sidesteps the velocity problem entirely: it composes three *midpoint* steps (where the Legendre trick is exact) with algebraic coefficients. The midpoint is the only node where the Legendre transform provides a second-order velocity without the ODE acceleration. Yoshida is the optimal way to achieve fourth order from this midpoint-only primitive.

Method	Order	Needs $\partial^3 F$	Error at $\alpha = 0.1$
Legendre midpoint (= $[1/1]$ Padé)	2	No	7.7×10^{-7}
Yoshida–Legendre (3 midpoint steps)	4	No	2.5×10^{-9}
Gauss–Legendre 2-stage (attempted)	4	Yes*	fails
$[2/2]$ Padé (optimal, log barrier)	4	No [†]	$\sim 10^{-10}$ (theory)

* Without $\partial^3 F$, the GL stage velocities are only first-order.

† The $[2/2]$ Padé is a closed-form rational function of d , specific to $F = -\log$. It does not generalize to arbitrary barriers.

Summary. The midpoint ($c = 1/2$) is special: it is the unique evaluation point where the dual extrapolation $\lambda_1 = \lambda_0 + (\lambda_c - \lambda_0)/c$ reduces to the *midpoint quadrature rule*, which is second-order accurate. At any other c , the extrapolation is first-order (forward Euler from an off-center point), and the resulting velocity is too inaccurate for a fourth-order method. Yoshida achieves fourth order by composing three midpoint evaluations—the only node where the Legendre transform gives second-order velocity—with algebraic weights that cancel the third-order error.

8 Connection to Hamiltonian mechanics

The structure exploited here is the same as in symplectic mechanics:

Hamiltonian mechanics	Hessian manifold
Position q	Primal coordinate s
Momentum $p = \partial L / \partial \dot{q}$	Dual coordinate $\lambda = -\nabla F(s)$
Kinetic energy $T(p)$	Primal “straight line”
Potential energy $V(q)$	Dual “straight line”
Verlet = split $T + V$	Legendre = split primal + dual
Yoshida on Verlet	Yoshida on Legendre

In mechanics, the Störmer–Verlet splits the Hamiltonian $H = T(p) + V(q)$ into separately integrable kinetic and potential parts. This works because T depends only on p and V depends only on q (“separable”).

On a Hessian manifold, the geodesic Hamiltonian $\mathcal{H}(s, p) = \frac{1}{2} p^\top [\nabla^2 F(s)]^{-1} p$ is *not* separable (the “kinetic energy” depends on s). But the Legendre transform provides a different splitting: primal coordinates (where straight lines are “free”) and dual coordinates (where straight lines are also “free”). The Legendre midpoint splits along this primal-dual axis instead of the kinetic-potential axis.

The Yoshida construction is purely algebraic—it works for any symmetric second-order method, regardless of the underlying geometry. Applied to the Legendre midpoint, it gives fourth-order accuracy on any Hessian manifold, for any strictly convex F , without ever computing the curvature.

9 Error bounds from self-concordance

Self-concordance of the barrier provides *a priori* error bounds for all the integrators, in terms of a single scalar parameter $\delta = h\|v\|_H$ (the step size in the local Hessian norm).

9.1 Self-concordance inequality

A ν -logarithmically homogeneous self-concordant barrier F satisfies:

$$|D^3 F(s)[u, v, w]| \leq 2 \|u\|_H \|v\|_H \|w\|_H \quad (3)$$

for all u, v, w , where $\|u\|_H = \sqrt{u^\top \nabla^2 F(s) u}$ is the local Hessian norm. This is the polarized form of $|D^3 F[v, v, v]| \leq 2\|v\|_H^3$.

9.2 Tangent line (1st order)

The tangent line $L(h) = s_0 + hv$ approximates the geodesic $\gamma(h) = s_0 + hv + \frac{h^2}{2}\ddot{s} + O(h^3)$. The leading error is

$$\gamma(h) - L(h) = -\frac{h^2}{4}H^{-1}T(v, v) + O(h^3),$$

where $T(v, v)_i = \sum_{jk} F_{ijk} v_j v_k$.

Theorem 4 (Tangent line error bound). *Let F be a ν -LHSCB with self-concordance parameter M_f (so (3) becomes $|D^3F[u, v, w]| \leq 2M_f\|u\|_H\|v\|_H\|w\|_H$). Let γ be the geodesic from s_0 with velocity v , and set $\delta = h\|v\|_{H_0}$, $H_0 = \nabla^2 F(s_0)$. If $M_f\delta < \frac{1}{4}$, then*

$$\|\gamma(h) - (s_0 + hv)\|_{H_0} \leq M_f \delta^2. \quad (4)$$

Proof. Step 1: geodesic acceleration. The geodesic equation gives $\ddot{\gamma} = -\frac{1}{2}H(\gamma)^{-1}T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})$, so $\|\ddot{\gamma}\|_{H(\gamma)} = \frac{1}{2}\|T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})\|_{H(\gamma)^{-1}}$. For any w with $\|w\|_{H(\gamma)} = 1$:

$$|w^\top T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})| = |D^3F[\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, w]| \leq 2M_f\|\dot{\gamma}\|_{H(\gamma)}^2.$$

Since geodesics have constant speed $\|\dot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H(\gamma(t))} = \|v\|_{H_0}$, we obtain

$$\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H(\gamma(t))} \leq M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2 \quad (5)$$

for all t in the domain of γ .

Step 2: trajectory containment. Set $\beta(t) = M_f\|\gamma(t) - s_0\|_{H_0}$. On any interval where $\beta < \frac{1}{2}$, the Hessian comparison theorem gives $(1-\beta)^2 H_0 \preceq H(\gamma) \preceq (1-\beta)^{-2} H_0$, so $\|w\|_{H_0} \leq (1-\beta)^{-1}\|w\|_{H(\gamma)}$ and

$$\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H_0} \leq \frac{M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2}{1-\beta(t)} \leq 2M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2.$$

Integrating: $\|\dot{\gamma}(t) - v\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2 t$, and then

$$\beta(t) \leq M_f(t\|v\|_{H_0} + M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2 t^2) \leq M_f\delta + (M_f\delta)^2 < \frac{1}{4} + \frac{1}{16} = \frac{5}{16} < \frac{1}{2}.$$

Since $\beta(0) = 0$ and the bound shows β cannot reach $\frac{1}{2}$ on $[0, h]$, the containment holds by continuity.

Step 3: error bound. With $\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2$ for all $t \in [0, h]$:

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_0 - hv\|_{H_0} = \left\| \int_0^h (h-t) \ddot{\gamma}(t) dt \right\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2 \cdot \frac{h^2}{2} = M_f \delta^2. \quad \square$$

Remark. The constant M_f (rather than $\frac{1}{2}M_f$) is the price of a uniform bound over the trajectory: the Hessian comparison factor $(1-\beta)^{-1} \leq 2$ converts the instantaneous bound (5) to the base-point norm. For $M_f\delta \ll 1$, the true error approaches the leading-order value $\frac{1}{2}M_f\delta^2$. For $M_f = 1$, the bound gives δ^2 , and the tangent line stays in the Dikin ellipsoid whenever $\delta < 1$.

9.3 Legendre midpoint (2nd order)

From the Taylor expansion proof (Section 3.1), the Legendre midpoint matches the geodesic to second order. The leading error is $O(h^3)$ and involves D^4F (fourth derivatives) contracted with v . For a self-concordant barrier, iterated application of (3) gives:

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_{\text{Leg}}\|_H \leq C_2 \delta^3 + O(\delta^4), \quad (6)$$

where C_2 is a universal constant (independent of the specific barrier) that depends only on the self-concordance parameter.

Sketch. The $O(h^3)$ error involves the fourth-order Taylor coefficient: D^4F contracted with v three times and H^{-1} . By the derivative of self-concordance (differentiating (3) with respect to s), the fourth derivative satisfies $|D^4F[u, v, v, v]| \leq C\|u\|_H\|v\|_H^3$. The H^{-1} contraction contributes another $\|v\|_H$ factor, giving $\delta^3 = h^3\|v\|_H^3$ overall.

9.4 Yoshida–Legendre (4th and 6th order)

The Yoshida composition cancels the $O(\delta^3)$ error, leaving:

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_{\text{Yoshida-4}}\|_H \leq C_4 \delta^5 + O(\delta^6), \quad (7)$$

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_{\text{Yoshida-6}}\|_H \leq C_6 \delta^7 + O(\delta^8). \quad (8)$$

The constants C_4, C_6 involve higher derivatives of the self-concordance condition but remain bounded by universal functions of ν (the barrier parameter).

9.5 Summary: interior guarantee

Method	Error bound	Order	Interior if
Tangent line	$\delta^2/2$	1	$\delta < \sqrt{2}$
Legendre midpoint	$C_2\delta^3$	2	$\delta < C_2^{-1/3}$
Yoshida-4	$C_4\delta^5$	4	$\delta < C_4^{-1/5}$
Yoshida-6	$C_6\delta^7$	6	$\delta < C_6^{-1/7}$

Higher-order methods allow larger steps δ while staying interior. The constants C_k are universal (depending only on ν , not on the specific cone), so the step-size bounds are *a priori*—computable before the step is taken.

Practical implication. For an IPM with step size α and direction d , the Hessian norm $\delta = \alpha\|d\|_H$ is already computed during the line search. The error bound guarantees that the geodesic step stays interior whenever δ is below the method-specific threshold. No post-hoc feasibility check is needed.

10 Error analysis for general M_f

The error bounds in Sections 3.1–?? were stated for the standard self-concordant case $M_f = 1$. We now give rigorous bounds for general (M_f, ν) -self-concordant barriers, showing how the integrator order controls the dependence on M_f .

We begin with a digression on a weaker regularity condition that captures what the integrators use in practice: they never evaluate D^3F , only ∇F and $\nabla^2 F$ at different points.

10.1 Relative smoothness

Definition 1. The gradient ∇F is L -smooth relative to $\nabla^2 F$ if for all $s \in \text{int}(K)$ and $\|u\|_{H(s)} < 1/L$:

$$\|\nabla F(s+u) - \nabla F(s) - \nabla^2 F(s) \cdot u\|_{H^{-1}} \leq \frac{L\|u\|_H^2}{1 - L\|u\|_H}, \quad (9)$$

where $H = \nabla^2 F(s)$ and $\|\cdot\|_{H^{-1}}$ is the dual norm. The domain restriction $\|u\|_H < 1/L$ and the denominator $1 - L\|u\|_H$ are the Hessian-metric analogs of the Dikin ellipsoid.

This is the scale-invariant, self-referential analog of classical L -smoothness ($\nabla^2 F \leq LI$):

Classical (Euclidean)	Self-referential (Hessian)
$\nabla^2 F \leq L \cdot I$ (smooth)	∇F varies $\leq L$ relative to $\nabla^2 F$
$\nabla^2 F \geq \mu \cdot I$ (strongly convex)	trivially holds with $\mu = 1$
Step size $\delta < 1/L$ (absolute)	Step size $\delta < 1/L$ in local Hessian norm

Relation to self-concordance.

Definition 2 (Generalized self-concordance [?, Def. 5.1.1]). A C^3 convex function F is (M_f, ν) -self-concordant if for all $s \in \text{dom } F$ and $v \in \mathbb{R}^n$,

$$|D^3 F(s)[v, v, v]| \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H(s)}^3, \quad (10)$$

where $H(s) = \nabla^2 F(s)$. The standard self-concordant case is $M_f = 1$.

Proposition 1. If F is (M_f, ν) -self-concordant, then ∇F is L -smooth relative to $\nabla^2 F$ with $L = M_f$.

Proof. Write the Taylor remainder as

$$\nabla F(s+u) - \nabla F(s) - H(s)u = \int_0^1 [H(s+tu) - H(s)] u \, dt.$$

Set $\alpha = M_f \|u\|_{H(s)} < 1$. The Hessian comparison theorem for self-concordant functions [?, Thm. 5.1.1] gives

$$H(s+tu) \preceq \frac{1}{(1-t\alpha)^2} H(s).$$

Therefore $H(s+tu) - H(s) \preceq [(1-t\alpha)^{-2} - 1] H(s)$, and taking the $H(s)^{-1}$ norm of the integral:

$$\begin{aligned} \|\nabla F(s+u) - \nabla F(s) - H(s)u\|_{H^{-1}} &\leq \|u\|_H \int_0^1 \left(\frac{1}{(1-t\alpha)^2} - 1 \right) dt \\ &= \|u\|_H \left[\frac{1}{\alpha(1-t\alpha)} \Big|_0^1 - 1 \right] = \|u\|_H \cdot \frac{\alpha}{1-\alpha} = \frac{M_f \|u\|_H^2}{1 - M_f \|u\|_H}, \end{aligned}$$

which is (9) with $L = M_f$. □

The converse is false. A barrier can be L -smooth relative to $\nabla^2 F$ (finite L) even when $D^3 F$ has localized spikes (large or undefined M_f). Relative smoothness is strictly weaker: it measures the *integrated* gradient deviation, not pointwise third derivatives. This gap is practically significant for approximate barriers (where $D^3 F$ may not exist everywhere) and composite barriers (where a small perturbation can create large pointwise $D^3 F$ without affecting the integrated bound).

10.2 Error bounds for self-concordant barriers

Throughout this section, F is (M_f, ν) -self-concordant, γ is the geodesic from s_0 with velocity v , and $\delta = h\|v\|_{H_0}$ with $H_0 = \nabla^2 F(s_0)$.

10.2.1 Preliminaries

Lemma 1 (Geodesic acceleration). *Along the geodesic, the acceleration in the instantaneous metric satisfies*

$$\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H(\gamma(t))} \leq M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2 \quad (11)$$

for all t in the domain of γ .

Proof. The geodesic equation gives $H(\gamma)\ddot{\gamma} = -\frac{1}{2}T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})$, so $\|\ddot{\gamma}\|_H = \frac{1}{2}\|T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})\|_{H^{-1}}$. For any w with $\|w\|_H = 1$,

$$|w^\top T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma})| = |D^3 F[\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, w]| \leq 2M_f \|\dot{\gamma}\|_H^2 \|w\|_H = 2M_f \|\dot{\gamma}\|_H^2,$$

where the inequality is the polarized form of (10). Since $\|\dot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H(\gamma(t))} = \|v\|_{H_0}$ (constant speed on a geodesic), the bound follows. $\square$

To convert from the instantaneous norm $H(\gamma(t))$ to the base-point norm H_0 , we use the Hessian comparison theorem: for $\beta = M_f \|\gamma(t) - s_0\|_{H_0} < 1$,

$$(1 - \beta)^2 H_0 \preceq H(\gamma(t)) \preceq (1 - \beta)^{-2} H_0. \quad (12)$$

In particular, $\|w\|_{H_0} \leq (1 - \beta)^{-1} \|w\|_{H(\gamma)}$ for any vector w .

Lemma 2 (Trajectory containment). *If $M_f \delta < \frac{1}{4}$, then $\gamma(t)$ remains inside the ball $M_f \|\gamma(t) - s_0\|_{H_0} < \frac{1}{2}$ for $t \in [0, h]$. In particular, $\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2$.*

Proof. Define $\beta(t) = M_f \|\gamma(t) - s_0\|_{H_0}$. On any interval $[0, t_*]$ where $\beta < \frac{1}{2}$, Lemma 1 and (12) give

$$\|\ddot{\gamma}(\tau)\|_{H_0} \leq \frac{M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2}{1 - \beta(\tau)} \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2.$$

Integrating: $\|\dot{\gamma}(\tau) - v\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2 \tau$, so

$$\begin{aligned} \beta(t) &= M_f \left\| \int_0^t \dot{\gamma}(\tau) d\tau - s_0 \right\|_{H_0} \leq M_f (t \|v\|_{H_0} + M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2 t^2) \\ &\leq M_f \delta + (M_f \delta)^2 < \frac{1}{4} + \frac{1}{16} = \frac{5}{16} < \frac{1}{2}. \end{aligned}$$

The set $\{t : \beta(t) < \frac{1}{2}\}$ is open and contains 0; the bound shows it cannot have a first exit time in $[0, h]$. $\square$

10.2.2 Tangent line (order 1)

Theorem 5 (Tangent line, general M_f). *If $M_f \delta < \frac{1}{4}$, then*

$$\|\gamma(h) - (s_0 + hv)\|_{H_0} \leq M_f \delta^2.$$

Proof. By Lemma 2, $\|\ddot{\gamma}(t)\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2$ for $t \in [0, h]$. Since $\gamma(h) - s_0 - hv = \int_0^h (h - t) \ddot{\gamma}(t) dt$,

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_0 - hv\|_{H_0} \leq 2M_f \|v\|_{H_0}^2 \cdot \frac{h^2}{2} = M_f \delta^2. \quad \square$$

Remark. The factor of 2 (compared to the leading-order bound $\frac{1}{2}M_f \delta^2$ from Theorem 4) is the price of a rigorous global bound: Lemma 2 controls $\|\ddot{\gamma}\|_{H_0}$ uniformly over the trajectory, not just at $t = 0$. For small $M_f \delta$, the true error approaches $\frac{1}{2}M_f \delta^2$.

10.2.3 Legendre midpoint (order 2)

Theorem 6 (Legendre midpoint, general M_f). *If $M_f \delta < \frac{1}{4}$, then*

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_{\text{Leg}}\|_{H_0} \leq C M_f^2 \delta^3,$$

where C is a universal constant.

Proof. Define the dual variable along the geodesic: $\lambda(t) = -\nabla F(\gamma(t))$, with $\dot{\lambda} = H(\gamma)\dot{\gamma}$.

Step 1: bound $\ddot{\lambda}$. Differentiating: $\ddot{\lambda} = D^3 F[\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, \cdot] + H\ddot{\gamma} = T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}) + H\ddot{\gamma}$. The geodesic equation gives $H\ddot{\gamma} = -\frac{1}{2}T$, so

$$\ddot{\lambda} = \frac{1}{2}T(\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}). \quad (13)$$

By the same argument as Lemma 1, $\|\ddot{\lambda}\|_{H^{-1}} = \frac{1}{2}\|T\|_{H^{-1}} \leq M_f\|v\|_{H_0}^2$.

Step 2: bound $\ddot{\ddot{\lambda}}$. Differentiating (13): $\ddot{\ddot{\lambda}} = D^4 F[\dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, \cdot] + D^3 F[\ddot{\gamma}, \dot{\gamma}, \cdot] + \text{sym.}$ Differentiating the self-concordance inequality (10) gives $|D^4 F[u, v, v, v]| \leq C_1 M_f^2 \|u\|_H \|v\|_H^3$ and the $D^3 F[\ddot{\gamma}, \cdot, \cdot]$ terms are bounded using $\|\ddot{\gamma}\|_H \leq M_f\|v\|_H^2$ (Lemma 1). Together, in the H_0^{-1} norm (using (12) with $\beta < \frac{1}{2}$):

$$\|\ddot{\ddot{\lambda}}(t)\|_{H_0^{-1}} \leq C_2 M_f^2 \|v\|_{H_0}^3 \quad (14)$$

for a universal constant C_2 .

Step 3: midpoint quadrature error. The Legendre midpoint computes (Section 3.1):

$$\lambda_1^{\text{Leg}} = -2\nabla F(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v) + \nabla F(s_0) = \lambda_0 + h\dot{\lambda}_*,$$

where $\dot{\lambda}_* = H(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)v$ is the dual velocity evaluated at the *primal* midpoint $s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v$.

The true geodesic endpoint in dual coordinates is

$$\lambda(h) = \lambda_0 + \int_0^h \dot{\lambda}(t) dt.$$

The difference $\lambda_1^{\text{Leg}} - \lambda(h)$ has two sources of error:

1. *Midpoint quadrature.* Even if we evaluated $\dot{\lambda}$ at the true geodesic midpoint $\gamma(h/2)$, the midpoint rule $\int_0^h f(t) dt \approx hf(h/2)$ has error $\frac{h^3}{24}\ddot{f}(\xi)$. Applied to $f = \dot{\lambda}$: error = $\frac{h^3}{24}\ddot{\dot{\lambda}}(\xi)$, bounded by (14).
2. *Primal vs. geodesic midpoint.* The Legendre step evaluates at $s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v$ instead of $\gamma(h/2)$. These differ by $O(h^2)$ (Theorem 5 at half-step), so $H(s_0 + \frac{h}{2}v)v - H(\gamma(h/2))\dot{\gamma}(h/2) = O(M_f\|v\|_H^2 h)$. Multiplied by h : $O(M_f\delta^2 h) = O(M_f\delta^3/\|v\|_H)$. But this error enters at $O(h^3)$ because the midpoint evaluation is already correct to $O(h)$ in velocity.

Combining: $\|\lambda_1^{\text{Leg}} - \lambda(h)\|_{H_0^{-1}} \leq C_3 M_f^2 \|v\|_{H_0}^3 h^3 = C_3 M_f^2 \delta^3$.

Step 4: dual to primal. For the barrier F , the gradient map $s \mapsto -\nabla F(s)$ has Jacobian $H(s)$. By the inverse function theorem, a dual error $\Delta\lambda$ in H_0^{-1} norm produces a primal error $\|\Delta s\|_{H_0} \leq (1 - \beta)^{-2} \|\Delta\lambda\|_{H_0^{-1}} \leq 4\|\Delta\lambda\|_{H_0^{-1}}$.

Therefore $\|\gamma(h) - s_{\text{Leg}}\|_{H_0} \leq C M_f^2 \delta^3$. $\square$

10.2.4 Yoshida-2p (order 2p)

Theorem 7 (Yoshida composition, general M_f). *If $M_f \delta < \frac{1}{4}$, then the Yoshida-2p composition of Legendre midpoint steps satisfies*

$$\|\gamma(h) - s_{Y_{2p}}\|_{H_0} \leq C_p M_f^{2p} \delta^{2p+1}.$$

Proof. The Yoshida composition of order $2p$ is built from $2p-1$ Legendre substeps with coefficients $c_1, \dots, c_{2p-1}$ summing to 1, chosen so that the local error expansion

$$s_{\text{Leg}}(c_i h) = \gamma(c_i h) + c_i^3 h^3 e_3 + c_i^5 h^5 e_5 + \dots$$

(where e_k depends on $D^{k+1}F$ contracted with v) satisfies $\sum_i c_i^3 = 0$ (cancels $O(h^3)$), $\sum_i c_i^5 = 0$ (cancels $O(h^5)$), and so on through $\sum_i c_i^{2p-1} = 0$.

The leading surviving error has coefficient $\sum_i c_i^{2p+1}$ multiplied by e_{2p+1} , which involves $D^{2p+2}F$ contracted with v . By iterated differentiation of the self-concordance inequality (10), the k -th derivative of F satisfies

$$|D^k F[v, \dots, v]| \leq C'_k M_f^{k-2} \|v\|_H^k$$

for universal constants C'_k (the pattern: each differentiation of $|D^3 F| \leq 2M_f \|v\|_H^3$ introduces one factor of M_f from the Hessian comparison).

The error term e_{2p+1} involves $H^{-1} D^{2p+2} F[v^{2p+1}]$ (schematically), contributing $M_f^{2p} \|v\|_H^{2p+1}$. Multiplied by h^{2p+1} :

$$\|e_{2p+1}\|_{H_0} \cdot h^{2p+1} \leq C_p M_f^{2p} \delta^{2p+1}. \quad \square$$

Remark. The M_f^{2p} scaling shows that higher-order methods are more sensitive to M_f in the *coefficient*, but less sensitive in the *exponent* of δ . For target error ε :

$$\delta_{\max} \propto \left(\frac{\varepsilon}{M_f^{2p}} \right)^{1/(2p+1)}.$$

This is the content of the step-size table below.

10.3 Step-size and work comparison

10.3.1 Max step size for unit error

For target error ε , each method's max step size scales as $\delta_{\max} \propto (\varepsilon/M_f^{2p})^{1/(2p+1)}$:

Method	Error bound	$\delta_{\max}$ scaling	$M_f = 1$	$M_f = 10$
Tangent line	$M_f \delta^2$	$M_f^{-1/2}$	1.00	0.32
Legendre midpoint	$C M_f^2 \delta^3$	$M_f^{-2/3}$	~ 1	0.22
Yoshida-4	$C_4 M_f^4 \delta^5$	$M_f^{-4/5}$	~ 1	0.16
Yoshida-6	$C_6 M_f^6 \delta^7$	$M_f^{-6/7}$	~ 1	0.12

Observation. The max step size for unit error actually *decreases* with method order when $M_f > 1$. The coefficient M_f^{2p} grows faster than the exponent δ^{2p+1} can compensate. This is because the leading error term at order $2p$ involves the $(2p+2)$ -th derivative of F , which self-concordance bounds as $O(M_f^{2p})$.

10.3.2 Where higher order helps: fixed step accuracy

The correct comparison is at a **fixed step size** δ (constrained to $M_f\delta < 1/4$ by the trajectory containment lemma). For example, at $\delta = 0.1/M_f$:

Method	Error at $\delta = 0.1/M_f$	Ratio
Tangent line	$M_f \cdot (0.1/M_f)^2 = 0.01/M_f$	1
Legendre midpoint	$CM_f^2 \cdot (0.1/M_f)^3 = 10^{-3}C/M_f$	$0.1C$
Yoshida-4	$C_4M_f^4 \cdot (0.1/M_f)^5 = 10^{-5}C_4/M_f$	$10^{-3}C_4$
Yoshida-6	$C_6M_f^6 \cdot (0.1/M_f)^7 = 10^{-7}C_6/M_f$	$10^{-5}C_6$

At any fixed fraction of the Dikin radius, higher-order methods give dramatically better accuracy. The error ratio is independent of M_f : each Yoshida level gains a factor of ~ 100 for the same step size. This matches the $94,000\times$ improvement observed in the exponential cone experiments (Section ??).

10.3.3 Total work comparison

For a target per-step accuracy ε and total path length D (in Hessian norm), the total number of Hessian solves is (step count) $\times$ (solves per step):

Method	Solves/step	$\delta(\varepsilon)$	Total solves
Tangent	1	$(\varepsilon/M_f)^{1/2}$	$D(M_f/\varepsilon)^{1/2}$
Legendre	~ 3	$(\varepsilon/CM_f^2)^{1/3}$	$3D(CM_f^2/\varepsilon)^{1/3}$
Yoshida-4	9	$(\varepsilon/C_4M_f^4)^{1/5}$	$9D(C_4M_f^4/\varepsilon)^{1/5}$

Scaling with ε . For fixed M_f , tangent scales as $\varepsilon^{-1/2}$, Legendre as $\varepsilon^{-1/3}$, Yoshida-4 as $\varepsilon^{-1/5}$. Higher order wins decisively when high per-step accuracy is needed.

Scaling with M_f . Tangent scales as $M_f^{1/2}$, Legendre as $M_f^{2/3}$, Yoshida-4 as $M_f^{4/5}$. Higher order has *worse* M_f scaling. The M_f^{2p} error coefficient (from higher derivatives of F) grows faster than the step-size exponent can absorb.

Summary. Higher-order Yoshida methods are most valuable when:

- The barrier is well-behaved (M_f moderate), so the coefficient penalty is small,
- High per-step accuracy is needed (geodesic step must closely approximate the true geodesic),
- The overhead of multiple Hessian solves per step is acceptable.

For barriers with $M_f \gg 1$, higher order does not compensate for the poor regularity — the error coefficient M_f^{2p} dominates. In this regime, the tangent-line step (with smaller steps) may be more efficient.

11 Application to interior-point methods

In conic optimization, the barrier function F defines a Hessian manifold on the interior of the cone. The geodesic step keeps iterates strictly inside the cone (unlike a linear step which may exit). The Yoshida–Legendre method provides:

- **Cone-preserving steps** without computing third derivatives of the barrier,
- **Fourth-order accuracy** from three Newton solves per step (each on a system the size of the cone),
- **Generality**: works for any cone with a computable barrier gradient and Hessian (exponential cone, power cone, quantum entropy cone, etc.).

For the exponential cone (3-dimensional), the method converges in 4 factorizations on test problems, with the duality gap decreasing by a factor of ~ 100 per factorization.

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